

Finite-size T-duality electrodynamics in (2+1) dimensions

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(Dated: June 19, 2026)

We develop a finite-size formulation of T-duality-deformed electrostatics in $(2 + 1)$ dimensions. The T-duality form factor regularises the ultraviolet behaviour of the planar static Green function, while finite volume and boundary conditions control the infrared sector. We first rederive the self-energy-subtracted infinite-plane interaction, which is finite at the origin and recovers the logarithmic Coulomb law at large distances. We then define the corresponding Green function on general domains via the spectral calculus of the Laplacian and work out explicit realisations on the square torus, the grounded half-plane, and the grounded strip. The torus implements charge neutrality through zero-mode subtraction, whereas Dirichlet boundaries produce finite image and self-energy effects. Finally, we introduce an additive-constant-free running interaction dimension and show that the ultraviolet flow to one dimension survives in finite volume, while the infrared behaviour is geometry-dependent.

I. INTRODUCTION

In two spatial dimensions, electrostatics occupies a marginal position: the Green function of the Laplacian is neither Coulombic nor linearly confining, but logarithmic. This elementary fact makes $(2 + 1)$ -dimensional electrodynamics an unusually sensitive arena for testing ultraviolet regularisation, infrared boundary conditions, and the interplay between local gauge dynamics and nonlocal modifications. It also gives the theory a double physical relevance. On the high energy side, three-dimensional gauge theories exhibit distinctive infrared and topological features, including gauge invariant mass generation through Chern–Simons terms and nontrivial compact-gauge-field effects [1, 2]. On the condensed matter side, planar electromagnetic kernels appear in thin films, vortices, quantum Hall systems, strange metals, and other effectively two-dimensional media, where sample geometry and boundary conditions are not idealisations but part of the physical problem [3–5]. A further motivation comes from the use of nonlocal kernels as effective descriptions of short-distance physics. In string theory, T-duality relates compactification radii R and α'/R , thereby tying ultraviolet and infrared scales in a way that has no point particle analogue [6, 7]. Padmanabhan’s path integral duality proposal implements a closely related idea at the level of particle propagation, namely, that invariance under an inversion of path length introduces a zero-point length and modifies the propagator with a Bessel function form factor [8]. Subsequent work connected this zero-point length structure to string fluctuations and T-duality corrections [9, 10]. In field theoretic applications, the same mechanism has been used to regularise static gravitational and electromagnetic potentials, replacing point source singularities by finite short-distance profiles controlled by a length ℓ_0 [11, 12]. The planar case is especially delicate. In ordinary $(2 + 1)$ -dimensional Maxwell theory, the static potential between charges behaves as $\ln(\mu r)$, where μ is an infrared scale. Thus, the same logarithm encodes both short-distance and long-distance singular behaviour. Recent work on T-duality-deformed $(2 + 1)$ -dimensional electrodynamics showed that the zero-point length kernel softens the short-distance behaviour while retaining the logarithmic large distance growth [13]. However, the infinite plane is not the natural endpoint of the problem. The persistence of the infrared logarithm means that any physical prediction requires either an infrared prescription, a neutralising background, or a finite geometry. This issue is not merely technical because, in finite planar samples, the allowed modes, zero-mode subtraction, and boundary conditions determine the electrostatic energy.

The present work addresses this gap by formulating T-duality-deformed planar electrostatics directly on finite and bounded domains. Rather than imposing the T-duality form factor only in momentum space on $\mathbb{R}^2$, we define the nonlocal static kernel through the spectral calculus of the Laplacian on a domain Ω . If $-\nabla_\Omega^2 u_n = \lambda_n u_n$, the T-duality Green function is obtained by weighting each nonzero mode with the factor $\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n})/\lambda_n$. This construction is natural for self-adjoint elliptic operators and parallels standard treatments of fractional and nonlocal operators on bounded domains [14, 15]. It also makes explicit which part of the physics is universal (the ultraviolet smoothing controlled by ℓ_0) and which part is geometry-dependent (the infrared spectrum and the boundary response). Our

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central question is therefore how the T-duality length ℓ_0 modifies electrostatic interactions in finite $(2+1)$ -dimensional geometries, and how the familiar logarithmic potential and its regularised short-distance limit are recovered when the system size is taken to infinity? We answer this by deriving the spectral Green function for general domains, then working out explicit finite-volume and boundary examples. The square torus provides a controlled infrared regulator via zero-mode removal and yields an exact mode-sum expression for the self-energy-subtracted pair potential. The grounded half-plane and related geometries isolate boundary effects and clarify when image-type constructions survive the nonlocal deformation. This is important because nonlocal electrodynamics need not obey the same boundary intuitions as local Maxwell theory. Notice that in related nonlocal models, the usual image method can fail [16]. The purpose of this paper is to provide a reproducible finite-size framework for T-duality-deformed $(2+1)$ -dimensional electrodynamics. The construction gives well-defined interaction energies in finite samples, identifies the infinite-plane potential as a controlled limit, and separates ultraviolet regularisation from infrared geometry. Beyond its role as a consistency check on the planar T-duality kernel, the analysis is intended to make the model usable in contexts where boundaries, sample size, and mode discreteness are experimentally meaningful, particularly in effective planar condensed matter systems.

The paper is organised as follows. We first review the static T-duality kernel and its corrected infinite-plane Green function. We then define the spectral Green function on a general domain, derive the toroidal finite-volume potential, and analyse boundary geometries such as the half-plane. We close by discussing finite-size corrections, dimensional-flow diagnostics, and possible condensed-matter applications.

II. T-DUALITY KERNEL AND CORRECTED INFINITE-PLANE GREEN FUNCTION

The starting point is the T-duality-modified Abelian gauge theory obtained by replacing the Maxwell kinetic operator by a nonlocal form factor. In the static sector, the relevant operator is a function of the positive spatial Laplacian, and we write

$$f(k) := \ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k), \quad (1)$$

where $k = |\mathbf{k}|$, K_1 is the modified Bessel function of the second kind, and ℓ_0 is the zero-point length. The same form factor appears in Padmanabhan's path-integral-duality propagator and in its string-theoretic T-duality realisation [8–10]. In the gauge theory implementation, the free Lagrangian may be written schematically as

$$\mathcal{L}_{\text{free}} = -\frac{1}{4} F_{\mu\nu} \mathcal{O} F^{\mu\nu}, \quad \mathcal{O} = \left[\ell_0 \sqrt{\Delta} K_1 \left(\ell_0 \sqrt{\Delta} \right) \right]^{-1}, \quad (2)$$

with Δ replaced by $-\nabla^2$ for static Euclidean spatial configurations. This construction was used previously to regularise four-dimensional electrostatic and gravitational potentials [11, 12], and more recently to study the marginal $(2+1)$ -dimensional case [13]. For conserved external sources, the longitudinal part of the gauge propagator does not contribute. The static interaction between two point charges, therefore, reduces to a scalar Green function with a momentum-space kernel

$$\tilde{G}_{\infty, \ell_0}(\mathbf{k}) = \frac{f(k)}{k^2} = \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k^2}. \quad (3)$$

We use the Fourier convention

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k^2} e^{i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}}. \quad (4)$$

For two static charges Q and Q' , separated by $\mathbf{r} = \mathbf{x}_1 - \mathbf{x}_2$, the cross-term interaction is

$$V_{\text{int}}(r) = QQ' G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r). \quad (5)$$

In two spatial dimensions $G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r)$ is not itself an infrared-finite quantity. Indeed, since $\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k) \rightarrow 1$ as $k \rightarrow 0$, the integrand behaves as $1/k^2$ at small momentum, and the radial integral contains the usual logarithmic zero-mode divergence. The physically meaningful free-space quantity for a neutral pair is therefore the self-energy-subtracted difference

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) - G_{\infty, \ell_0}(0) = \int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k^2} (e^{i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}} - 1), \quad (6)$$

which is finite for all r . Equivalently, for opposite charges $Q' = -Q$, we define the positive separation energy

$$\Delta V_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) \equiv V_{\text{int}}(r) - V_{\text{int}}(0) = Q^2 [G_{\infty, \ell_0}(0) - G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r)]. \quad (7)$$

We now evaluate this quantity exactly. A useful way to perform the calculation is to interpret the T-duality form factor as a smearing of the source. The Green function satisfies

$$-\nabla^2 G_{\infty, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \rho_{\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}), \quad (8)$$

where

$$\rho_{\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k) e^{i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}}. \quad (9)$$

This equation is equivalent to the original nonlocal Green-function equation

$$\frac{-\nabla^2}{f(\sqrt{-\nabla^2})} G_{\infty, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \delta^{(2)}(\mathbf{r}), \quad (10)$$

but it has the advantage of isolating the nonlocality into an effective charge profile. We use the standard Schwinger-Basset representation of the modified Bessel function,

$$z K_1(z) = \int_0^\infty d\alpha \exp\left(-\alpha - \frac{z^2}{4\alpha}\right) \quad z > 0, \quad (11)$$

which is a special case of the integral representations of K_ν [17]. With $z = \ell_0 k$, this gives

$$\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k) = \int_0^\infty d\alpha \exp\left(-\alpha - \frac{\ell_0^2 k^2}{4\alpha}\right). \quad (12)$$

Substituting into ρ_{ℓ_0} yields

$$\rho_{\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \int_0^\infty d\alpha e^{-\alpha} \int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \exp\left(-\frac{\ell_0^2 k^2}{4\alpha} + i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}\right). \quad (13)$$

The Gaussian integral is

$$\int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \exp(-ak^2 + i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{4\pi a} \exp\left(-\frac{r^2}{4a}\right), \quad a = \frac{\ell_0^2}{4\alpha}. \quad (14)$$

Therefore

$$\int \frac{d^2 k}{(2\pi)^2} \exp\left(-\frac{\ell_0^2 k^2}{4\alpha} + i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{r}\right) = \frac{\alpha}{\pi \ell_0^2} \exp\left(-\frac{\alpha r^2}{\ell_0^2}\right). \quad (15)$$

It follows that

$$\rho_{\ell_0}(r) = \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \int_0^\infty d\alpha \alpha \exp\left[-\alpha \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2}\right)\right]. \quad (16)$$

Using

$$\int_0^\infty d\alpha \alpha e^{-A\alpha} = \frac{1}{A^2}, \quad A > 0, \quad (17)$$

we obtain the normalised T-duality charge density

$$\rho_{\ell_0}(r) = \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2}\right)^{-2}. \quad (18)$$

This profile is regular at the origin and algebraically suppressed at large radius. It also has a unit total charge

$$\int d^2 r \rho_{\ell_0}(r) = 2\pi \int_0^\infty dr r \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2}\right)^{-2} = 1 \quad (19)$$

Thus, the T-duality kernel is equivalent, in the static infinite-plane problem, to replacing a point source by the finite distribution ρ_{ℓ_0} . We now solve the radial Poisson equation (8). Since $G_{\infty, \ell_0} = G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r)$, we have

$$\frac{d}{dr} \left(r \frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} \right) = -r \rho_{\ell_0}(r). \quad (20)$$

Regularity at $r = 0$ requires $rG'_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) \rightarrow 0$. Integrating from 0 to r , we get

$$r \frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = - \int_0^r dR R \rho_{\ell_0}(R) = - \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \int_0^r dR R \left(1 + \frac{R^2}{\ell_0^2} \right)^{-2}, \quad (21)$$

where we made use of (18). By means of the substitution

$$u = 1 + \frac{R^2}{\ell_0^2}, \quad (22)$$

the integral in (21) can be readily computed and we obtain

$$\frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = - \frac{r}{2\pi(r^2 + \ell_0^2)}. \quad (23)$$

This derivative is infrared finite and uniquely determines the electric field. Integrating once more yields the corrected infinite-plane Green function

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = G_{\infty, \ell_0}(0) - \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right), \quad (24)$$

where $G_{\infty, \ell_0}(0)$ denotes an additive infrared-dependent constant. Since the absolute constant is not fixed on the infinite plane, the unambiguous quantity is the difference

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}(0) - G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (25)$$

For a neutral pair with charges Q and $-Q$, the self-energy-subtracted separation energy is therefore

$$\Delta V_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (26)$$

Let us briefly compare this result with the previously quoted infinite-plane expression for the same static kernel. Starting from the Fourier representation used in [13], the r -dependent part of the Green function is fixed unambiguously by differentiation, i.e. it satisfies (23) which integrates to Eq. (26), up to the additive infrared constant of the two-dimensional Green function. Hence, the difference with Eq. (18) of [13] is not a choice of additive normalisation. It affects the r -dependent part of the potential and therefore the electric field. In the dimensional regularisation calculation of [13], the finite contribution generated by the $\mathcal{O}(\epsilon)$ term in $\gamma(1 + \epsilon/2, u)$ must be kept because it is multiplied by the pole $2/\epsilon$. With this contribution included, the large distance coefficient is $Q^2/(2\pi)$, and the short distance neutral-pair energy behaves as $Q^2 r^2/(4\pi \ell_0^2)$. The qualitative conclusion that the T-duality scale removes the short-distance divergence is unchanged, but the normalisation and the scaling formulae derived from the infinite-plane potential are modified. As an independent check, the same result can be verified directly from the Fourier-Bessel representation. Angular integration gives

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = \frac{1}{2\pi} \int_0^\infty dk \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k} J_0(kr) = \frac{\ell_0}{2\pi} \int_0^\infty dk K_1(\ell_0 k) J_0(kr), \quad (27)$$

which is logarithmically infrared divergent. Differentiating removes the zero-mode ambiguity, i.e.

$$\frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = - \frac{1}{2\pi} \int_0^\infty dk \ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k) J_1(kr). \quad (28)$$

Using the same integral representation,

$$\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k) = \int_0^\infty d\alpha \exp \left(-\alpha - \frac{\ell_0^2 k^2}{4\alpha} \right), \quad (29)$$

we find

$$\frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = -\frac{1}{2\pi} \int_0^\infty d\alpha e^{-\alpha} \int_0^\infty dk e^{-\ell_0^2 k^2 / (4\alpha)} J_1(kr). \quad (30)$$

The elementary Bessel integral [18]

$$\int_0^\infty dk e^{-ak^2} J_1(kr) = \frac{1}{r} \left[1 - \exp\left(-\frac{r^2}{4a}\right) \right], \quad a > 0, \quad (31)$$

with a defined as in (14) gives

$$\frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = -\frac{1}{2\pi r} \int_0^\infty d\alpha e^{-\alpha} \left(1 - e^{-\alpha r^2 / \ell_0^2} \right). \quad (32)$$

The remaining integral is elementary, namely

$$\int_0^\infty d\alpha e^{-\alpha} \left[1 - e^{-\alpha r^2 / \ell_0^2} \right] = \frac{r^2}{r^2 + \ell_0^2}. \quad (33)$$

Hence, we again end up with (23), and therefore it integrates to the same logarithm. Several checks follow immediately. First, at a short distance,

$$\Delta V_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \left[\frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} - \frac{r^4}{2\ell_0^4} + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{r^6}{\ell_0^6}\right) \right], \quad r \ll \ell_0. \quad (34)$$

Thus, the separation energy is finite at the origin and rises quadratically for $r/\ell_0 \ll 1$. The corresponding electric field of a charge Q is

$$E_r(r) = -Q \frac{dG_{\infty, \ell_0}}{dr} = \frac{Qr}{2\pi(r^2 + \ell_0^2)}, \quad (35)$$

so $E_r(r) \sim Qr/(2\pi\ell_0^2)$ near the origin and vanishes at $r = 0$. Second, at a large distance,

$$\Delta V_{\infty, \ell_0}(r) = \frac{Q^2}{2\pi} \ln\left(\frac{r}{\ell_0}\right) + \frac{Q^2 \ell_0^2}{4\pi r^2} + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{\ell_0^4}{r^4}\right), \quad r \gg \ell_0. \quad (36)$$

The leading term is the standard logarithmic Coulomb growth in two spatial dimensions, while the subleading terms encode the finite zero-point-length correction. Finally, the dimensions are consistent because in $(2+1)$ dimensions Q^2 carries the dimension of mass, whereas the logarithm is dimensionless. This derivation also clarifies the role of the infrared ambiguity. The absolute Green function $G_{\infty, \ell_0}(r)$ contains an additive constant inherited from the zero mode of the two-dimensional Laplacian. This constant may be fixed by an infrared regulator, a neutralising background, or a finite-volume prescription. However, the subtracted free-space interaction $\Delta V_{\infty, \ell_0}(r)$ is independent of that choice. The finite-volume constructions developed in the following sections provide a systematic way to replace the arbitrary infinite-plane constant by the spectrum and zero-mode prescription of a physical planar domain.

III. SPECTRAL T-DUALITY GREEN FUNCTIONS ON BOUNDED DOMAINS

The infinite-plane construction is diagonal in momentum space. On a finite planar domain, however, translational invariance is generally lost, and the momentum variable is no longer the natural label of the static modes. The appropriate replacement is the spectral resolution of the spatial Laplacian. This point is especially important for nonlocal theories because on a bounded domain, a nonlocal operator is not specified by its Fourier symbol alone, but also by the choice of self-adjoint realisation of the underlying elliptic operator. This is well known in the theory of fractional and more general nonlocal elliptic operators, where spectral, restricted integral, and extension-based definitions can lead to distinct boundary problems [15, 19–21].

Let $\Omega \subset \mathbb{R}^2$ be a bounded connected domain with sufficiently regular boundary $\partial\Omega$, or a compact quotient such as the square torus treated in the next section. We denote by $A_B := -\Delta_B$ a non-negative self-adjoint realisation of the spatial Laplacian on $L^2(\Omega)$, with boundary condition B . For example, B may correspond to Dirichlet boundary conditions for a grounded boundary, Neumann boundary conditions for a reflecting or insulating boundary, Robin

boundary conditions, or periodic boundary conditions on a torus. We assume that A_B has a compact resolvent, so that its spectrum is discrete and there exists an orthonormal basis of eigenfunctions $\{u_n\}$ satisfying

$$A_B u_n = \lambda_n u_n, \quad \int_{\Omega} d^2x u_n^*(x) u_m(x) = \delta_{nm}. \quad (37)$$

The eigenvalues obey

$$0 \leq \lambda_0 \leq \lambda_1 \leq \lambda_2 \leq \dots, \quad \lambda_n \rightarrow \infty. \quad (38)$$

In this section, we first formulate the construction in the compact-resolvent case, where the spectral resolution is a discrete sum. For the noncompact boundary geometries considered below, such as the half-plane and the infinite strip, the same functional calculus is understood through the corresponding continuous spectral resolution, or equivalently through the heat kernel. Moreover, for Dirichlet boundary conditions, one has $\lambda_0 > 0$. For Neumann or periodic boundary conditions, the constant function is a zero mode, $\lambda_0 = 0$. In the latter case, the inverse Laplacian is defined only on the orthogonal complement of the zero mode. We denote the corresponding projector by $P_{\perp} = 1 - P_0$, where P_0 is the orthogonal projector onto $\ker A_B$. Equivalently, all spectral sums below are restricted to $\lambda_n > 0$. The T-duality form factor is the positive function

$$F_{\ell_0}(\lambda) = \ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda}), \quad \lambda > 0, \quad (39)$$

with the continuous extension $F_{\ell_0}(0) = 1$, since $zK_1(z) \rightarrow 1$ as $z \rightarrow 0$. In the infinite plane, this is precisely the factor multiplying the ordinary static Maxwell propagator. On a bounded domain, we define the corresponding nonlocal static operator by spectral calculus, namely

$$\mathcal{L}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)} = A_B F_{\ell_0}(A_B)^{-1} \quad (40)$$

on the nonzero spectral subspace $P_{\perp} L^2(\Omega)$. Its inverse is

$$\mathcal{G}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)} = F_{\ell_0}(A_B) A_B^{-1} P_{\perp}. \quad (41)$$

Thus the T-duality Green function is the integral kernel of $\mathcal{G}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}$, i.e.

$$G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} \frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n})}{\lambda_n} u_n(x) u_n^*(x'). \quad (42)$$

When the boundary condition is clear from context, we suppress the superscript (B) . This definition is the finite-domain analogue of the momentum space replacement

$$\frac{1}{k^2} \longrightarrow \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k^2}. \quad (43)$$

The correspondence is simply

$$k^2 \longleftrightarrow \lambda_n, \quad e^{i\mathbf{k} \cdot \mathbf{x}} \longleftrightarrow u_n(x). \quad (44)$$

In particular, if $\Omega = \mathbb{R}^2$ formally, the spectral sum becomes the Fourier integral

$$G_{\mathbb{R}^2, \ell_0}(x, x') = \int \frac{d^2k}{(2\pi)^2} \frac{\ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)}{k^2} e^{i\mathbf{k} \cdot (x - x')}, \quad (45)$$

which is the infinite-plane kernel discussed in the previous section. The kernel G_{Ω, ℓ_0} is characterized by the Green equation

$$\mathcal{L}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)} G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(\cdot, x') = \delta_{\Omega}^{\perp}(\cdot, x'), \quad (46)$$

where

$$\delta_{\Omega}^{\perp}(x, x') = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} u_n(x) u_n^*(x') \quad (47)$$

is the spectral delta function on the nonzero-mode subspace. For Dirichlet boundary conditions, $\delta_\Omega^\perp$ coincides with the ordinary delta distribution on Ω . For Neumann or periodic boundary conditions,

$$\delta_\Omega^\perp(x, x') = \delta_\Omega(x, x') - \frac{1}{|\Omega|}, \quad (48)$$

so the zero mode is removed. This is the finite-volume counterpart of the infrared subtraction in the infinite-plane logarithmic Green function. Equivalently, applying the ordinary Laplacian to the Green function gives

$$A_B G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') = \rho_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x'), \quad (49)$$

with the effective T-duality-smeared spectral source

$$\rho_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} \ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n}) u_n(x) u_n^*(x'). \quad (50)$$

Thus, the nonlocality can be viewed in two equivalent ways. One may either keep a point source and replace the Maxwell operator A_B by $\mathcal{L}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}$, or keep the local Poisson operator A_B and replace the point source by the smeared distribution $\rho_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}$. In a finite volume, the smearing is controlled not only by ℓ_0 , but also by the spectrum and boundary condition of A_B . The construction is well-behaved for every fixed $\ell_0 > 0$. At a large eigenvalue, according to [22]

$$K_1(z) \sim \sqrt{\frac{\pi}{2z}} e^{-z}, \quad z \rightarrow \infty, \quad (51)$$

and therefore

$$\frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda})}{\lambda} \sim \sqrt{\frac{\pi \ell_0}{2}} \lambda^{-3/4} e^{-\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda}}. \quad (52)$$

The spectral coefficients are exponentially suppressed. Consequently, the T-duality Green function is ultraviolet finite and its diagonal value $G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x)$ is finite, in contrast with the ordinary two-dimensional Maxwell Green function. In the opposite limit, $F_{\ell_0}(\lambda) \rightarrow 1$, as $\ell_0 \rightarrow 0$, and one recovers the standard Green function of the Laplacian, namely

$$G_{\Omega, 0}^{(B)}(x, x') = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} \frac{u_n(x) u_n^*(x')}{\lambda_n}. \quad (53)$$

Thus ℓ_0 acts as a genuine ultraviolet regulator, while the infrared properties remain governed by the low-lying spectrum of the finite domain. A useful equivalent representation follows from the integral identity [18]

$$z K_1(z) = \int_0^\infty ds \exp\left(-s - \frac{z^2}{4s}\right). \quad (54)$$

For $\lambda > 0$, we have

$$\frac{F_{\ell_0}(\lambda)}{\lambda} = \int_0^\infty ds e^{-s} \int_{\ell_0^2/(4s)}^\infty d\tau e^{-\tau\lambda}. \quad (55)$$

Let

$$K_\Omega^{\perp, B}(\tau; x, x') = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} e^{-\tau\lambda_n} u_n(x) u_n^*(x') \quad (56)$$

be the heat kernel of A_B with the zero mode removed when present. Then

$$G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') = \int_0^\infty ds e^{-s} \int_{\ell_0^2/(4s)}^\infty d\tau K_\Omega^{\perp, B}(\tau; x, x'). \quad (57)$$

This formula makes the regularising role of the zero-point length explicit. The ordinary Green function would involve an integral of the heat kernel down to $\tau = 0$, where the two-dimensional heat kernel has its short-time singularity. The T-duality kernel replaces this by a weighted family of positive lower cutoffs $\tau = \ell_0^2/(4s)$, thereby softening

the ultraviolet behaviour while preserving the correct infrared spectral structure. For a static charge density $j(x)$ satisfying $P_0 j = 0$ whenever a zero mode is present, the scalar potential is

$$A_0(x) = \int_{\Omega} d^2 x' G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') j(x'). \quad (58)$$

Equivalently, if

$$j_n = \int_{\Omega} d^2 x u_n^*(x) j(x), \quad (59)$$

then (58) becomes

$$A_0(x) = \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} \frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n})}{\lambda_n} j_n u_n(x). \quad (60)$$

The corresponding electrostatic energy is the positive quadratic form

$$E_{\Omega, \ell_0}[j] = \frac{1}{2} \int_{\Omega} d^2 x \int_{\Omega} d^2 x' j(x) G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x, x') j(x') \quad (61)$$

or, spectrally,

$$E_{\Omega, \ell_0}[j] = \frac{1}{2} \sum_{\lambda_n > 0} \frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda_n})}{\lambda_n} |j_n|^2. \quad (62)$$

The positivity follows from $K_1(z) > 0$ for $z > 0$ and $\lambda_n > 0$ on the reduced spectral subspace. For point charges,

$$j(x) = \sum_a q_a \delta_{\Omega}(x, x_a), \quad (63)$$

the energy becomes

$$E_{\Omega, \ell_0} = \frac{1}{2} \sum_{a, b} q_a q_b G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x_a, x_b), \quad (64)$$

with the neutrality condition $\sum_a q_a = 0$ required for Neumann or periodic boundary conditions. Unlike in ordinary planar Maxwell theory, the diagonal terms $G_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)}(x_a, x_a)$ are finite for $\ell_0 > 0$. In a bounded geometry, these diagonal terms are generally position-dependent and encode the interaction of a charge with the boundary. For a neutral pair $+Q$ and $-Q$ at x and x' , one obtains

$$E_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(+, -)} = \frac{Q^2}{2} [G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x) + G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x', x') - 2G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x')]. \quad (65)$$

On a translationally invariant torus, this reduces to

$$E_{L, \ell_0}^{(+, -)}(r) = Q^2 [G_{L, \ell_0}(0) - G_{L, \ell_0}(r)], \quad (66)$$

which is the finite-volume analogue of the self-energy-subtracted infinite-plane potential. Several comments are in order. First, the spectral definition is not a naive restriction of the infinite-plane convolution kernel to Ω . It is a definition of the nonlocal theory on Ω , with the boundary condition incorporated before the nonlocal function of the Laplacian is formed. This is the natural choice when the T-duality correction is regarded as a function of the kinetic operator itself. Second, different self-adjoint realisations of $-\Delta$ correspond to different physical boundary conditions and therefore to different nonlocal Green functions. Third, the zero-mode subtraction in periodic or Neumann geometries is not optional since it is the finite-volume implementation of charge neutrality and is the bounded-domain counterpart of the additive infrared ambiguity of the logarithmic Green function on $\mathbb{R}^2$. The explicit geometries considered below are obtained by inserting the corresponding eigenvalues and eigenfunctions into the spectral kernel above. For the square torus, this yields a rapidly convergent Fourier series with the constant mode removed. For the noncompact boundary geometries considered below, the discrete spectral sum is replaced by the appropriate continuous spectral resolution or heat-kernel representation. The resulting Green functions satisfy the chosen boundary condition mode by mode or, equivalently, at the level of the Dirichlet heat kernel. In all cases, the infinite-plane result is recovered when the infrared scale set by the domain is sent to infinity while ℓ_0 is held fixed.

IV. FINITE AND BOUNDARY GEOMETRIES

The infinite-plane Green function derived above isolates the ultraviolet regularisation produced by the T-duality scale ℓ_0 , but it still inherits the infrared sensitivity of two-dimensional electrostatics. In a physical planar system, the infrared sector is fixed by the geometry, which may be represented by a finite sample, a periodic cell, a grounded edge, or a strip, thereby selecting a specific self-adjoint realisation of the Laplacian and, hence, a specific nonlocal Green function. In this section, we work out three canonical examples. The square torus gives a clean finite-volume regulator with the zero mode removed. The grounded half-plane and grounded strip exhibit boundary effects and show when image constructions survive the T-duality deformation. Finally, for noncompact domains such as the half-plane and the strip, the same functional calculus is understood via the continuous spectral resolution or the heat kernel.

A. Square torus and zero-mode subtraction

Let $\mathbb{T}_L^2 = \mathbb{R}^2/(L\mathbb{Z})^2$ be the square torus of side length L . The normalised eigenfunctions of the periodic Laplacian are

$$u_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{x}) = \frac{1}{L} e^{i\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{x}}, \quad \mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} = \frac{2\pi}{L} \mathbf{n}, \quad \mathbf{n} = (n_1, n_2) \in \mathbb{Z}^2, \quad (67)$$

with eigenvalues $\lambda_{\mathbf{n}} = k_{\mathbf{n}}^2$. The mode $\mathbf{n} = 0$ is the constant zero mode. Since the inverse Laplacian is defined only on the subspace orthogonal to constants, this mode must be removed. This is the finite-volume implementation of charge neutrality and is the toroidal analogue of the arbitrary additive constant in the infinite-plane logarithmic Green function. The T-duality Green function on the torus is therefore

$$G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{L^2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \in \mathbb{Z}^2 \setminus \{0\}} \frac{\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}} K_1(\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}})}{k_{\mathbf{n}}^2} e^{i\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{r}}, \quad (68)$$

where $\mathbf{r} = \mathbf{x} - \mathbf{x}'$. Equivalently, because the summand is even under the reflection $\mathbf{n} \mapsto -\mathbf{n}$, we can rewrite (68) as

$$G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{L^2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq 0} \frac{\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}} K_1(\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}})}{k_{\mathbf{n}}^2} \cos(\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{r}). \quad (69)$$

The normalisation is chosen so that the toroidal Green function has zero average, i.e.

$$\int_{\mathbb{T}_L^2} d^2x G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{x} - \mathbf{x}') = 0. \quad (70)$$

The corresponding Green equation is

$$-\nabla^2 G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \rho_{L,\ell_0}^\perp(\mathbf{r}), \quad (71)$$

where the finite-volume smeared source is

$$\rho_{L,\ell_0}^\perp(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{L^2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq 0} \ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}} K_1(\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}}) e^{i\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{r}}. \quad (72)$$

Using Poisson summation, this can be written as a periodized T-duality charge cloud with a uniform neutralising background

$$\rho_{L,\ell_0}^\perp(\mathbf{r}) = \sum_{\mathbf{m} \in \mathbb{Z}^2} \rho_{\infty,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r} + \mathbf{m}L) - \frac{1}{L^2}, \quad (73)$$

where the infinite-plane profile is

$$\rho_{\infty,\ell_0}(r) = \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right)^{-2}. \quad (74)$$

Thus, the zero-mode subtraction is not an arbitrary prescription because it is exactly the uniform background required to make the total source on the compact torus vanish,

$$\int_{\mathbb{T}_L^2} d^2x \rho_{L,\ell_0}^\perp(\mathbf{x}) = 0. \quad (75)$$

For a neutral pair consisting of charges $+Q$ and $-Q$ separated by $\mathbf{r}$, the finite-volume separation energy is the self-energy-subtracted quantity

$$\Delta V_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = Q^2 [G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{0}) - G_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r})]. \quad (76)$$

Substituting the Fourier series gives the exact positive mode sum

$$\Delta V_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{Q^2}{L^2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} \frac{\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}} K_1(\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}})}{k_{\mathbf{n}}^2} [1 - \cos(\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{r})]. \quad (77)$$

Each term is non-negative. Hence

$$\Delta V_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{0}) = 0, \quad (78)$$

as expected for a coincident neutral pair. For any fixed $\ell_0 > 0$ the sum is absolutely convergent because [22]

$$K_1(z) \sim \sqrt{\frac{\pi}{2z}} e^{-z}, \quad z \rightarrow \infty. \quad (79)$$

The T-duality scale therefore regularises the ultraviolet self-energy, while the compact geometry regulates the infrared sector. It is useful to introduce dimensionless variables $\boldsymbol{\xi} = \mathbf{r}/L$, and $\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$. Then $k_{\mathbf{n}} = 2\pi|\mathbf{n}|/L$, $\ell_0 k_{\mathbf{n}} = 2\pi\mathbf{a}|\mathbf{n}|$, and the pair energy takes the scale-invariant form

$$\mathcal{U}_{\mathbb{T}^2}(\boldsymbol{\xi}; \mathbf{a}) := \frac{\Delta V_{L,\ell_0}(\mathbf{r})}{Q^2} = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} \frac{\mathbf{a} K_1(2\pi\mathbf{a}|\mathbf{n}|)}{2\pi|\mathbf{n}|} [1 - \cos(2\pi\mathbf{n} \cdot \boldsymbol{\xi})]. \quad (80)$$

Because the square torus has only the discrete rotational symmetry of the lattice, the potential is a function of the vector $\boldsymbol{\xi}$, not only of $|\boldsymbol{\xi}|$. For a one-dimensional plot, it is convenient to choose an axial separation, $\boldsymbol{\xi} = (\xi, 0)$ with $0 \leq \xi \leq \frac{1}{2}$ as in Fig. 1, and define

$$\mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} \frac{\mathbf{a} K_1(2\pi\mathbf{a}|\mathbf{n}|)}{2\pi|\mathbf{n}|} [1 - \cos(2\pi n_1 \xi)]. \quad (81)$$

The natural comparison curve is the infinite-plane result evaluated at the same ratios $r/L = \xi$ and $\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$, i.e.

$$\mathcal{U}_{\infty}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{\xi^2}{\mathbf{a}^2} \right). \quad (82)$$

TABLE I: Convergence of the truncated square-torus mode sum used in Fig. 1. The cutoff N means $-N \leq n_1, n_2 \leq N$, with the zero mode omitted. The tail estimate is $K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N)/\pi$. The last column gives the direct convergence check on the plotting grid.

$\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$	N	$K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N)/\pi$	$\max_{0 \leq \xi \leq 1/2} \mathcal{U}_{2N} - \mathcal{U}_N $
0.020	164	9.79×10^{-11}	2.13×10^{-11}
0.050	66	8.61×10^{-11}	1.73×10^{-11}
0.100	33	8.61×10^{-11}	1.45×10^{-11}

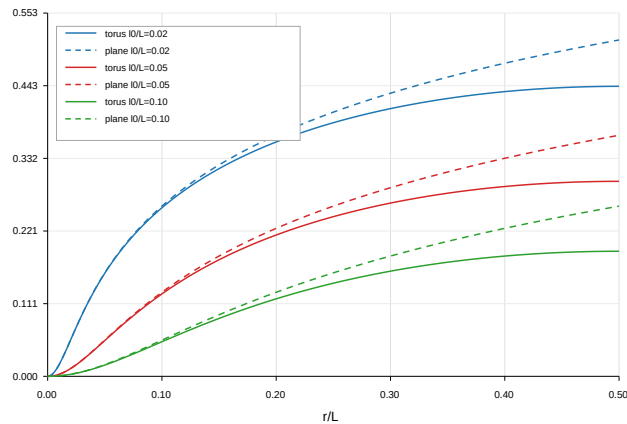


FIG. 1: Axial finite-volume T-duality potential (81) on the square torus. The solid curves show the zero-mode-subtracted toroidal pair energy $\mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(r, 0)/Q^2$ as a function of $\xi = r/L$, for $\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L \in \{0.02, 0.05, 0.10\}$. The dashed curves show the corrected infinite-plane reference potential (82). At small separations, the toroidal result approaches the infinite-plane potential, while at separations of order L , the finite geometry and zero-mode subtraction produce a bounded periodic interaction.

For the numerical evaluation of the axial torus potential, we truncate the lattice sum symmetrically,

$$\mathcal{U}_N(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \sum_{\substack{-N \leq n_1, n_2 \leq N \\ (n_1, n_2) \neq (0,0)}} \frac{\mathbf{a} K_1(2\pi\mathbf{a}|\mathbf{n}|)}{2\pi|\mathbf{n}|} [1 - \cos(2\pi n_1 \xi)]. \quad (83)$$

For every fixed $\mathbf{a} > 0$ this sum is exponentially convergent, because according to (79) $K_1(z) \sim \sqrt{\pi/(2z)} e^{-z}$ as $z \rightarrow \infty$. Thus, the effective damping scale in the lattice sum is set by $2\pi\mathbf{a}|\mathbf{n}|$. A useful estimate of the neglected tail is obtained by replacing the remaining lattice modes by a radial continuum integral. Using $0 \leq 1 - \cos(2\pi n_1 \xi) \leq 2$, one finds

$$|R_N(\xi; \mathbf{a})| \lesssim 2\mathbf{a} \int_N^\infty d\rho K_1(2\pi\mathbf{a}\rho) = \frac{1}{\pi} K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N). \quad (84)$$

We therefore choose N such that

$$\frac{1}{\pi} K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N) < 10^{-10}. \quad (85)$$

As an independent numerical check, we also compute

$$\epsilon_N = \max_{\xi \in [0, 1/2]} |\mathcal{U}_{2N}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) - \mathcal{U}_N(\xi; \mathbf{a})| \quad (86)$$

on the plotting grid. The values used in Fig. 1 are shown in Table I. In all cases, the direct difference between the N and $2N$ truncations is below 2.2×10^{-11} , so the visible deviations between the toroidal curves and the infinite-plane reference are finite-size effects rather than truncation artefacts. Moreover, Fig. 1 illustrates the separation between ultraviolet and infrared physics. At small $\xi = r/L$, with $s = r/\ell_0 = \xi/\mathbf{a}$ fixed, the toroidal curves follow the corrected infinite-plane result. At larger separations, the curves bend away from the infinite-plane logarithm because the torus

has no unbounded radial direction and the zero mode has been removed. The finite-volume potential is therefore a bounded periodic function, whereas the infinite-plane reference continues to grow logarithmically. As expected from the exponential factor $e^{-2\pi\mathfrak{a}|\mathbf{n}|}$, smaller values of $\mathfrak{a}$ require larger mode cutoffs. Furthermore, the values in Table I scale approximately as $N \propto 1/\mathfrak{a}$. Concerning (80), we observe that for $\xi \ll 1$ and $\mathfrak{a} \ll 1$, with $\xi/\mathfrak{a} = r/\ell_0$ fixed and the charge far from its periodic images, the toroidal result approaches this curve

$$\mathcal{U}_{\mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathfrak{a}) \longrightarrow \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{|\xi|^2}{\mathfrak{a}^2} \right). \quad (87)$$

Equivalently, we have

$$\lim_{L \rightarrow \infty} \Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right), \quad (88)$$

for fixed r and ℓ_0 . For small separations in a large torus, $r \ll \ell_0 \ll L$, one recovers the quadratic core found in the infinite plane, namely

$$\Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{r^4}{\ell_0^4}\right) + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{r^2}{L^2}\right). \quad (89)$$

For $\ell_0 \ll r \ll L$, the logarithmic planar behavior is recovered, that is

$$\Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = \frac{Q^2}{2\pi} \ln \left(\frac{r}{\ell_0} \right) + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{\ell_0^2}{r^2}\right) + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{r^2}{L^2}\right). \quad (90)$$

At separations comparable to L , however, the potential no longer follows an infinite-plane logarithm. It is a periodic, finite function determined by the discrete spectrum of the torus. We also notice that for numerical purposes the direct Fourier series is efficient when $2\pi\mathfrak{a}|\mathbf{n}|$ is not too small, because the T-duality factor suppresses large $|\mathbf{n}|$ exponentially. When $\mathfrak{a} \ll 1$, an Ewald-type representation is preferable, as in standard treatments of periodic long-range Green functions [23, 24]. Starting from the heat-kernel representation,

$$\frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda})}{\lambda} = \int_0^\infty ds e^{-s} \int_{\ell_0^2/(4s)}^\infty d\tau e^{-\tau\lambda}, \quad (91)$$

one obtains

$$\Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r}) = Q^2 \int_0^\infty ds e^{-s} \int_{\ell_0^2/(4s)}^\infty d\tau \left[K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{0}) - K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{r}) \right], \quad (92)$$

where

$$K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{L^2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \in \mathbb{Z}^2} e^{-\tau k_{\mathbf{n}}^2} e^{i\mathbf{k}_{\mathbf{n}} \cdot \mathbf{r}} \quad (93)$$

is the heat kernel on the square torus. By Poisson summation,

$$K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{r}) = \frac{1}{4\pi\tau} \sum_{\mathbf{m} \in \mathbb{Z}^2} \exp \left(-\frac{|\mathbf{r} + \mathbf{m}L|^2}{4\tau} \right). \quad (94)$$

The zero mode cancels in the difference $K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{0}) - K_{\mathbb{T}_L^2}(\tau; \mathbf{r})$. This form gives an alternative real-space representation and makes explicit how the finite-volume result interpolates between the ultraviolet scale ℓ_0 and the infrared scale L .

B. Grounded half-plane

We next consider the grounded half-plane $H = \{(x, y) \in \mathbb{R}^2 : y > 0\}$, with Dirichlet boundary condition $A_0(x, 0) = 0$. Let $X = (x, y)$, $X' = (x', y')$, and $X'_* = (x', -y')$ denote the mirror point of X' across the boundary. For the ordinary Dirichlet heat kernel on the half-plane, the method of images gives

$$K_H^D(\tau; X, X') = K_{\mathbb{R}^2}(\tau; X - X') - K_{\mathbb{R}^2}(\tau; X - X'_*). \quad (95)$$

Since the T-duality Green function is a spectral function of the Dirichlet Laplacian and admits a heat-kernel representation, the same antisymmetrisation holds for the T-duality kernel. Thus we find

$$G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X, X') = G_{\infty,\ell_0}(X - X') - G_{\infty,\ell_0}(X - X'_*). \quad (96)$$

The additive infrared constant in G_{∞,ℓ_0} cancels between the two terms. Using the subtracted infinite-plane kernel

$$G_{\infty,\ell_0}(R) = C_{\text{IR}} - \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{|R|^2}{\ell_0^2} \right), \quad (97)$$

we obtain the explicit grounded half-plane Green function

$$G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X, X') = -\frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(\frac{|X - X'|^2 + \ell_0^2}{|X - X'_*|^2 + \ell_0^2} \right). \quad (98)$$

This expression satisfies the boundary condition. Indeed, if X lies on $y = 0$, then $|X - X'| = |X - X'_*|$, and hence $G_{H,\ell_0}^D((x, 0), X') = 0$. In the limit $\ell_0 \rightarrow 0$, one recovers the standard two-dimensional Dirichlet Green function

$$G_{H,0}^D(X, X') = -\frac{1}{2\pi} \ln \left(\frac{|X - X'|}{|X - X'_*|} \right), \quad (99)$$

as expected from the ordinary method of images [25]. Applying the local Laplacian gives the boundary-adapted smeared source equation

$$-\nabla_X^2 G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X, X') = \rho_{\infty,\ell_0}(X - X') - \rho_{\infty,\ell_0}(X - X'_*), \quad (100)$$

where

$$\rho_{\infty,\ell_0}(R) = \frac{1}{\pi \ell_0^2} \left(1 + \frac{|R|^2}{\ell_0^2} \right)^{-2}. \quad (101)$$

Thus, the boundary problem is not obtained by simply cutting off the infinite-plane charge cloud at $y = 0$. The spectral Dirichlet construction produces a boundary-compatible smeared source through antisymmetrisation. Moreover, the diagonal value is finite

$$G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X, X) = \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{4y^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (102)$$

Consequently, the boundary-induced self-energy of a single charge Q at height y above the grounded edge is

$$U_{\text{self}}^D(y) = \frac{Q^2}{2} G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X, X) = \frac{Q^2}{8\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{4y^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (103)$$

The corresponding normal force is

$$F_y = -\frac{dU_{\text{self}}^D}{dy} = -\frac{Q^2 y}{\pi(\ell_0^2 + 4y^2)}. \quad (104)$$

Thus, the charge is attracted toward the grounded boundary. Near the boundary,

$$F_y = -\frac{Q^2}{\pi \ell_0^2} y + \mathcal{O}(y^3), \quad y \ll \ell_0, \quad (105)$$

so the zero-point length smooths the force. Far from the boundary,

$$F_y = -\frac{Q^2}{4\pi y} + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{\ell_0^2}{y^3}\right), \quad y \gg \ell_0, \quad (106)$$

which is the ordinary logarithmic two-dimensional image-force behaviour. For a neutral pair with charges $+Q$ and $-Q$ at X_1 and X_2 , the grounded half-plane energy is

$$E_H^{(+,-)} = \frac{Q^2}{2} [G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X_1, X_1) + G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X_2, X_2) - 2G_{H,\ell_0}^D(X_1, X_2)]. \quad (107)$$

Writing X_{2*} for the image of X_2 , this becomes

$$E_H^{(+,-)} = \frac{Q^2}{8\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{4y_1^2}{\ell_0^2} \right) + \frac{Q^2}{8\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{4y_2^2}{\ell_0^2} \right) + \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \ln \left(\frac{|X_1 - X_2|^2 + \ell_0^2}{|X_1 - X_{2*}|^2 + \ell_0^2} \right). \quad (108)$$

This formula separates the two boundary self-energies from the direct charge-anticharge interaction, which is modified by the image geometry. The fact that image construction works here is not automatic in arbitrary nonlocal electrodynamics. It follows because the nonlocal operator has been defined spectrally as a function of the Dirichlet Laplacian. For other nonlocal kernels or other boundary prescriptions, the ordinary image method can fail [16]. The spectral construction, therefore, identifies the precise condition under which the image intuition remains valid.

C. Grounded strip

As a second boundary example, we consider the infinite strip $S_W = \{(x, y) \in \mathbb{R}^2 : 0 < y < W\}$, with grounded boundaries $A_0(x, 0) = A_0(x, W) = 0$. The Dirichlet eigenfunctions are plane waves along the strip and standing waves in the transverse direction, that is

$$u_{km}(x, y) = \frac{1}{\sqrt{\pi W}} e^{ikx} \sin \left(\frac{m\pi y}{W} \right), \quad m = 1, 2, \dots, \quad (109)$$

with eigenvalues

$$\lambda_{km} = k^2 + \left(\frac{m\pi}{W} \right)^2. \quad (110)$$

The spectral T-duality Green function is therefore

$$G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X, X') = \frac{2}{W} \sum_{m=1}^{\infty} \sin \left(\frac{m\pi y}{W} \right) \sin \left(\frac{m\pi y'}{W} \right) \int_{-\infty}^{\infty} \frac{dk}{2\pi} \frac{\ell_0 \sqrt{k^2 + (m\pi/W)^2} K_1 \left(\ell_0 \sqrt{k^2 + (m\pi/W)^2} \right)}{k^2 + (m\pi/W)^2} e^{ik(x-x')}. \quad (111)$$

This representation is exact and follows directly from the spectral definition. It is often the most convenient starting point for numerical evaluation. Furthermore, there is also an image representation. Let us define the subtracted infinite-plane kernel as

$$G_{\infty, \ell_0}^{\text{sub}}(X) = -\frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{|X|^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (112)$$

Then the grounded-strip Green function is

$$G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X, X') = \sum_{p=-\infty}^{\infty} [G_{\infty, \ell_0}^{\text{sub}}(x - x', y - y' + 2pW) - G_{\infty, \ell_0}^{\text{sub}}(x - x', y + y' + 2pW)], \quad (113)$$

where the sum is understood symmetrically in p . This is the T-duality-regularised analogue of the standard alternating-image construction for a grounded strip. The image series can be summed in closed form. To this end, let $\mathcal{A} = \sqrt{(x - x')^2 + \ell_0^2}$. Using the Weierstrass product identity (see Secs. 4.22 and 4.36 in [17])

$$\prod_{p=-\infty}^{\infty} \frac{\mathcal{A}^2 + (y - y' + 2pW)^2}{\mathcal{A}^2 + (y + y' + 2pW)^2} = \frac{\cosh(\pi \mathcal{A}/W) - \cos(\pi(y - y')/W)}{\cosh(\pi \mathcal{A}/W) - \cos(\pi(y + y')/W)}, \quad (114)$$

one obtains

$$G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X, X') = -\frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left[\frac{\cosh(\pi \mathcal{A}/W) - \cos(\pi(y - y')/W)}{\cosh(\pi \mathcal{A}/W) - \cos(\pi(y + y')/W)} \right]. \quad (115)$$

This expression satisfies $G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D((x, 0), X') = G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D((x, W), X') = 0$. In the local limit $\ell_0 \rightarrow 0$, it reduces to the usual Dirichlet Green function in an infinite strip, that is

$$G_{S_W, 0}^D(X, X') = -\frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left[\frac{\cosh(\pi |x - x'|/W) - \cos(\pi(y - y')/W)}{\cosh[\pi |x - x'|/W] - \cos(\pi(y + y')/W)} \right]. \quad (116)$$

In the limit $W \rightarrow \infty$, with y and y' fixed, the strip result becomes the grounded half-plane expression

$$G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X, X') \longrightarrow -\frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(\frac{|X - X'|^2 + \ell_0^2}{|X - X'_*|^2 + \ell_0^2} \right). \quad (117)$$

The diagonal value in the strip is also finite

$$G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X, X) = \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left[\frac{\cosh(\pi \ell_0/W) - \cos(2\pi y/W)}{\cosh(\pi \ell_0/W) - 1} \right]. \quad (118)$$

It vanishes as $y \rightarrow 0$ or $y \rightarrow W$, and it is maximal at the centre of the strip, $y = W/2$. The corresponding boundary-induced self-energy is

$$U_{\text{self}}^{S_W}(y) = \frac{Q^2}{8\pi} \ln \left[\frac{\cosh(\pi \ell_0/W) - \cos(2\pi y/W)}{\cosh(\pi \ell_0/W) - 1} \right]. \quad (119)$$

For a neutral pair in the strip, the energy is again obtained from

$$E_{S_W}^{(+,-)} = \frac{Q^2}{2} [G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_1) + G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X_2, X_2) - 2G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_2)]. \quad (120)$$

This expression is finite without any additional ultraviolet subtraction. The finite zero-point length regularises the coincident limit, while the grounded boundaries remove the logarithmic infrared ambiguity. The torus, half-plane, and strip illustrate complementary aspects of the same spectral construction. The torus preserves translational invariance but requires zero-mode subtraction. The grounded half-plane fixes the additive constant through a boundary condition and produces a finite image interaction. The strip combines two boundaries and admits both a spectral mode expansion and a closed image-summed expression. In all cases, the ultraviolet behaviour is controlled by ℓ_0 , whereas the infrared behaviour is determined by the geometry.

V. RUNNING INTERACTION DIMENSION IN FINITE VOLUME

The preceding sections show that the T-duality scale ℓ_0 regularises the ultraviolet behaviour of the planar static Green function, whereas finite volume or boundary conditions regulate the infrared sector. It is therefore natural to ask how the associated *running dimension* behaves once both effects are included. In this section, we define an additive constant-free dimension diagnostic from the neutral-pair energy and evaluate it for the infinite plane, the square torus, the grounded half-plane, and the grounded strip. The notion of scale-dependent dimension is common in quantum gravity contexts, especially in analyses based on spectral dimension and diffusion processes [26–31]. The diagnostic used here is different. It is not a spectral dimension of an auxiliary random walk. It is an interaction dimension extracted from the scaling of an electrostatic observable. This distinction is important because different probes of a nonlocal or quantum geometry need not define the same scale-dependent dimension. Our goal is therefore not to identify a unique geometric dimension, but to quantify how the static interaction interpolates between its short-distance T-duality core and its infrared finite-volume behaviour. We also stress that the quantity introduced below is an operational interaction dimension. It measures the local logarithmic response of a static neutral-pair energy under a change of separation. It is not the spectral dimension of a diffusion process on Ω , nor is it meant to define a unique intrinsic or fractal dimension of the underlying space. Different probes of a nonlocal theory can define different scale-dependent dimensions. The purpose of $\mathbb{D}_\Delta$ and $\mathbb{D}_F$ is narrower, i.e. they quantify how the T-duality-modified electrostatic interaction crosses over from its ultraviolet regularised core to the geometry-controlled infrared regime. For a neutral pair with charges $+Q$ and $-Q$ at x and x' , the natural finite observable is

$$\Delta V_\Omega(x, x') = \frac{Q^2}{2} [G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x) + G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x', x') - 2G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x')]. \quad (121)$$

This quantity is invariant under the shift

$$G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x') \longrightarrow G_{\Omega, \ell_0}(x, x') + C, \quad (122)$$

because the total charge of the pair is zero. Thus, it avoids the additive infrared ambiguity of the two-dimensional Green function. If the two points are varied along a one-parameter path with separation r , we define $\mathcal{V}_\Omega(r) := \Delta V_\Omega(r)/Q^2$. The potential-based running interaction dimension is then

$$\mathbb{D}_\Delta(r) = 3 - \frac{\partial \ln \mathcal{V}_\Omega(r)}{\partial \ln r}. \quad (123)$$

This definition is the finite-observable analogue of the potential-scaling definition used in previous work on T-duality electrodynamics [12, 13]. The difference is that the quantity entering the logarithm is now an unambiguous neutral-pair energy, rather than a Green function defined only up to an additive constant. A complementary diagnostic can be defined by the force

$$\mathcal{F}_\Omega(r) = \frac{\partial \mathcal{V}_\Omega(r)}{\partial r}, \quad (124)$$

as

$$\mathbb{D}_F(r) = 2 - \frac{\partial \ln |\mathcal{F}_\Omega(r)|}{\partial \ln r}. \quad (125)$$

For ordinary planar electrostatics, one has $\mathcal{F}(r) \propto r^{-1}$, and hence $\mathbb{D}_F = 3$, the topological spacetime dimension. The force-based definition is also insensitive to additive constants, but in finite geometries, it becomes singular at points where the force vanishes. For this reason, $\mathbb{D}_\Delta$ is the better global diagnostic in finite volume, while $\mathbb{D}_F$ is useful locally on monotonic branches of the potential.

A. Infinite-plane reference limit

The corrected infinite-plane neutral-pair energy is

$$\mathcal{V}_\infty(r) = \frac{1}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{r^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (126)$$

Introducing $s = r/\ell_0$, we find

$$\frac{\partial \ln \mathcal{V}_\infty}{\partial \ln r} = \frac{2s^2}{(1+s^2) \ln(1+s^2)}. \quad (127)$$

Therefore

$$\mathbb{D}_\Delta^{(\infty)}(s) = 3 - \frac{2s^2}{(1+s^2) \ln(1+s^2)}. \quad (128)$$

At a short distance,

$$\mathbb{D}_\Delta^{(\infty)}(s) = 1 + s^2 - \frac{5}{6}s^4 + \mathcal{O}(s^6), \quad s \ll 1. \quad (129)$$

Thus, the interaction probes an effective one-dimensional ultraviolet scaling. At large distance,

$$\mathbb{D}_\Delta^{(\infty)}(s) = 3 - \frac{1}{\ln s} + \mathcal{O}\left(\frac{1}{s^2 \ln s}\right), \quad s \gg 1, \quad (130)$$

so the classical value is recovered only logarithmically slowly. The force-based diagnostic gives a slightly different interpolation. Since

$$\mathcal{F}_\infty(r) = \frac{1}{2\pi} \frac{r}{r^2 + \ell_0^2}, \quad (131)$$

one obtains

$$\mathbb{D}_F^{(\infty)}(s) = 2 - \frac{\partial}{\partial \ln s} \ln \left(\frac{s}{1+s^2} \right) = \frac{1+3s^2}{1+s^2}. \quad (132)$$

Thus $\mathbb{D}_F^{(\infty)}(0) = 1$, and $\mathbb{D}_F^{(\infty)}(\infty) = 3$. The limiting values agree with the potential-based definition, although the interpolation is different. This illustrates why the running dimension used here should be read as an operational interaction diagnostic rather than an intrinsic geometric dimension.

B. Square torus

For the square torus, the neutral-pair energy is given by (77). We also recall that by writing $\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$, and $\boldsymbol{\xi} = \mathbf{r}/L$, we can define the dimensionless energy as

$$\mathcal{U}_{\mathbb{T}^2}(\boldsymbol{\xi}; \mathbf{a}) = \frac{\Delta V_{L, \ell_0}(\mathbf{r})}{Q^2} = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) [1 - \cos(2\pi \mathbf{n} \cdot \boldsymbol{\xi})], \quad w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) = \frac{\mathbf{a} K_1(2\pi \mathbf{a} |\mathbf{n}|)}{2\pi |\mathbf{n}|}. \quad (133)$$

Because the square torus is not rotationally invariant, the running dimension is path-dependent at separations comparable with L . Let $\boldsymbol{\xi} = \xi \hat{e}$, where $|\hat{e}| = 1$, and define $q_{\mathbf{n}}(\hat{e}) = 2\pi \mathbf{n} \cdot \hat{e}$. Then

$$\mathcal{U}_{\hat{e}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) [1 - \cos(q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi)]. \quad (134)$$

The potential-based running dimension along this path is

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = 3 - \frac{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi \sin(q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi)}{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) [1 - \cos(q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi)]}. \quad (135)$$

This expression is the appropriate quantity to plot as a function of $r/L = \xi$ for fixed $\ell_0/L = \mathbf{a}$. The axial direction, $\hat{e} = (1, 0)$ with $0 \leq \xi \leq 1/2$, is a convenient canonical choice (see Fig. 2). Notice that the ultraviolet limit is universal. Moreover, Fig. 2 shows the potential-based running interaction dimension along the axial direction of the square torus. The derivative entering $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}$ is evaluated analytically from the truncated Fourier series, rather than by finite differences. Thus, if

$$\mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) [1 - \cos(2\pi n_1 \xi)], \quad (136)$$

then

$$\xi \partial_{\xi} \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) (2\pi n_1 \xi) \sin(2\pi n_1 \xi). \quad (137)$$

At $\xi = 0$, the plotted value is the limiting value $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta} = 1$. At the axial symmetry point $\xi = 1/2$, periodicity implies $\partial_{\xi} \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}} = 0$, and therefore $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta} = 3$. Furthermore, Fig. 2 illustrates the distinction between ultraviolet and infrared behaviour. The ultraviolet limit is controlled locally by the T-duality core and is insensitive to the global geometry because the neutral-pair energy is quadratic at small separation (see Eq. 139), so $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta} \rightarrow 1$. By contrast, the infrared behaviour is geometry-dependent. The infinite-plane reference continues to approach the classical value 3 only logarithmically, while the toroidal curves saturate at separations of order L because the potential is bounded, periodic, and zero-mode subtracted. The numerical convergence of the running-dimension curves is checked separately from the convergence of the potential. This is necessary because $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}$ is a logarithmic derivative and therefore contains the ratio $\xi \partial_{\xi} \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}} / \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}$. Although both numerator and denominator are smooth for $\mathbf{a} > 0$, they vanish as ξ^2 near the origin. In the plot, we therefore use the limiting value $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}(0) = 1$ at $\xi = 0$, and evaluate the ratio only for $\xi > 0$. The derivative is computed analytically from the truncated Fourier series, not by finite differences. Furthermore, the numerical evaluation of Fig. 2 uses the same symmetric lattice truncation as the toroidal potential. For each value of $\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$, the cutoff N is chosen according to (85). The running dimension is then computed from the analytic logarithmic derivative of the truncated sum. As a direct convergence check, the curve obtained with cutoff N is compared with the curve obtained with cutoff $2N$ on the plotting grid, i.e.

$$\epsilon_N^{(\mathbb{D})} = \max_{\xi \in [0, 1/2]} |\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, N}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) - \mathbb{D}_{\Delta, 2N}(\xi; \mathbf{a})|. \quad (138)$$

The values are reported in Table II. The direct N versus $2N$ comparison is zero at the printed numerical precision for all three curves, confirming that the observed saturation of the toroidal running dimension is a finite-size effect rather than a truncation artifact.

Expanding at small ξ gives

$$\mathcal{U}_{\hat{e}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = A_2(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) \xi^2 + A_4(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) \xi^4 + \mathcal{O}(\xi^6), \quad (139)$$

TABLE II: Convergence of the truncated square-torus mode sum used for the running-dimension plot in Fig. 2. The cutoff N means $-N \leq n_1, n_2 \leq N$, with the zero mode omitted. The tail estimate is $K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N)/\pi$. The last column gives the direct comparison between the curves computed with cutoffs N and $2N$ on the plotting grid. The value 0.00 in the last column means zero at the printed double-precision output of the convergence script.

$\mathbf{a} = \ell_0/L$	N	$K_0(2\pi\mathbf{a}N)/\pi$	$\max_{\xi} \mathbb{D}_{\Delta,2N} - \mathbb{D}_{\Delta,N} $
0.020	328	7.79×10^{-20}	0.00
0.050	132	6.04×10^{-20}	0.00
0.100	66	6.04×10^{-20}	0.00

where

$$A_2(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = \frac{1}{2} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}}^2, \quad A_4(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = -\frac{1}{24} \sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}}^4. \quad (140)$$

For every fixed $\mathbf{a} > 0$, these sums are finite because the Bessel factor gives exponential suppression at large $|\mathbf{n}|$. Consequently,

$$\frac{\partial \ln \mathcal{U}_{\hat{e}}}{\partial \ln \xi} = 2 + 2 \frac{A_4(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e})}{A_2(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e})} \xi^2 + \mathcal{O}(\xi^4), \quad (141)$$

and hence

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = 1 + \kappa_{\mathbb{T}^2}(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) \xi^2 + \mathcal{O}(\xi^4) \quad (142)$$

with

$$\kappa_{\mathbb{T}^2}(\mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = \frac{1}{6} \frac{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}}^4}{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}}^2}. \quad (143)$$

Thus

$$\lim_{\xi \rightarrow 0} \mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = 1. \quad (144)$$

The ultraviolet dimensional reduction is therefore not an artefact of the infinite plane. It survives finite volume because it is controlled by the local quadratic core of the T-duality-regularised potential. The large-volume limit reproduces the infinite-plane result. If $\mathbf{a} \rightarrow 0$, $\xi \rightarrow 0$, and $s = \xi/\mathbf{a} = r/\ell_0$ fixed, the toroidal sum approaches the continuum integral and $\mathcal{U}_{\hat{e}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) \rightarrow (4\pi)^{-1} \ln(1 + s^2)$. As a consequence, $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) \rightarrow \mathbb{D}_{\Delta}^{(\infty)}(s)$. The infrared behaviour is qualitatively different from that of the infinite plane. On the torus, there is no limit $r \rightarrow \infty$. The largest inequivalent separations are of order L . The potential is bounded, periodic, and smooth. For the axial path, periodicity implies $\mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(\xi; \mathbf{a}) = \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(1 - \xi; \mathbf{a})$, so

$$\left. \frac{\partial \mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}}{\partial \xi} \right|_{\xi=1/2} = 0. \quad (145)$$

Since $\mathcal{U}_{\text{ax}}(1/2; \mathbf{a})$ is finite and nonzero, the running dimension saturates at

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(1/2; \mathbf{a}, \hat{x}) = 3. \quad (146)$$

Thus, finite volume cuts off the logarithmic growth and replaces the infinite-plane slow approach to 3 by a geometry-controlled saturation at the scale $r \sim L$. The force-based toroidal diagnostic is

$$\mathbb{D}_{F, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = 2 - \xi \frac{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}}^2 \cos(q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi)}{\sum_{\mathbf{n} \neq \mathbf{0}} w_{\mathbf{n}}(\mathbf{a}) q_{\mathbf{n}} \sin(q_{\mathbf{n}} \xi)}. \quad (147)$$

It again satisfies

$$\lim_{\xi \rightarrow 0} \mathbb{D}_{F, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathbf{a}, \hat{e}) = 1, \quad (148)$$

but it becomes ill-defined at symmetry points where the force vanishes, such as $\xi = 1/2$ along the axial path. This is why $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}$ is the more robust finite-volume diagnostic.

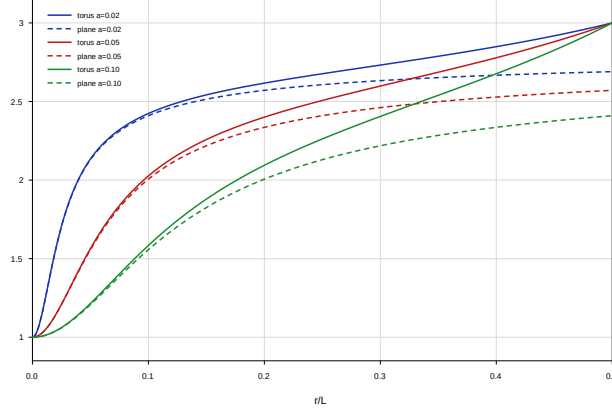


FIG. 2: Potential-based running interaction dimension for the corrected infinite plane and for the square torus. The horizontal axis is $\xi = r/L$, and $\mathfrak{a} = \ell_0/L$. Solid curves show the toroidal result $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, \mathbb{T}^2}(\xi; \mathfrak{a}, \hat{x})$ obtained from the zero-mode-subtracted axial mode sum (see Eq. (135)), while dashed curves show the corrected infinite-plane reference $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}^{(\infty)}(\xi/\mathfrak{a})$. All curves approach the ultraviolet limit $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta} \rightarrow 1$ as $\xi \rightarrow 0$. The finite-torus curves saturate to $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta} = 3$ at the maximally separated axial point $\xi = 1/2$, where the potential is smooth and periodic, whereas the infinite-plane reference approaches 3 only through the logarithmic large-distance limit.

C. Grounded half-plane

The grounded half-plane is not finite in area, but the boundary fixes the additive constant and screens the neutral-pair energy at large separation parallel to the wall. Consider two charges at the same height $y > 0$ above the grounded boundary, separated by a horizontal distance R , that is $X_1 = (0, y)$, and $X_2 = (R, y)$. From the half-plane Green function (98), the neutral-pair energy is

$$\Delta V_H(R; y) = Q^2 [G_{H, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_1) - G_{H, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_2)]. \quad (149)$$

More precisely, we find

$$\Delta V_H(R; y) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} h_H(\eta, b), \quad (150)$$

where $\eta = R/\ell_0$, $b = (2y)/\ell_0$, and

$$h_H(\eta, b) = \ln \left[\frac{(1+b^2)(1+\eta^2)}{1+b^2+\eta^2} \right]. \quad (151)$$

This function vanishes at $R = 0$ and tends to a finite constant as $R \rightarrow \infty$, that is $h_H(0, b) = 0$, and $h_H(\infty, b) = \ln(1+b^2)$. The corresponding running interaction dimension is

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, H}(\eta; b) = 3 - \frac{2\eta^2 b^2}{(1+\eta^2)(1+b^2+\eta^2) \ln \left[\frac{(1+b^2)(1+\eta^2)}{1+b^2+\eta^2} \right]}. \quad (152)$$

At short horizontal separation, we have

$$h_H(\eta, b) = \frac{b^2}{1+b^2} \eta^2 + \mathcal{O}(\eta^4), \quad \eta \ll 1, \quad (153)$$

and therefore $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, H}(\eta; b) = 1 + \mathcal{O}(\eta^2)$. The same ultraviolet dimensional reduction is recovered. At large horizontal separation,

$$h_H(\eta, b) = \ln(1+b^2) - \frac{b^2}{\eta^2} + \mathcal{O}(\eta^{-4}), \quad \eta \gg 1, \quad (154)$$

which gives

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta,H}(\eta; b) = 3 - \frac{2b^2}{\eta^2 \ln(1+b^2)} + \mathcal{O}(\eta^{-4}). \quad (155)$$

Thus, the interaction dimension approaches the classical value algebraically. The grounded boundary has removed the logarithmic infrared growth. Hence, the energy does not diverge, but saturates to the finite value

$$\Delta V_H(\infty; y) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} \ln \left(1 + \frac{4y^2}{\ell_0^2} \right). \quad (156)$$

D. Grounded strip

The grounded strip provides a fully confined transverse geometry and a stronger infrared cutoff. Consider the strip $0 < y < W$ with Dirichlet boundary conditions at $y = 0$ and $y = W$. We place the two charges at equal height y and separate them by a distance R along the strip, i.e. $X_1 = (0, y)$, and $X_2 = (R, y)$. Using the strip Green function (115) yields the following expression for the neutral-pair energy

$$\Delta V_{S_W}(R; y) = Q^2 [G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_1) - G_{S_W, \ell_0}^D(X_1, X_2)]. \quad (157)$$

Let us introduce the dimensionless variables $u = R/W$, $\hat{a} = \ell_0/W$, $v = y/W$, and define

$$\alpha(u) = \pi \sqrt{u^2 + \hat{a}^2}, \quad \alpha_0 = \pi \hat{a}, \quad c_v = \cos(2\pi v). \quad (158)$$

Then the neutral-pair energy becomes

$$\Delta V_{S_W}(R; y) = \frac{Q^2}{4\pi} h_S(u; \hat{a}, v), \quad h_S(u; \hat{a}, v) = \ln \left[\frac{\cosh \alpha_0 - c_v}{\cosh \alpha_0 - 1} \frac{\cosh \alpha(u) - 1}{\cosh \alpha(u) - c_v} \right]. \quad (159)$$

with $h_S(0; \hat{a}, v) = 0$, and

$$h_S(\infty; \hat{a}, v) := \lim_{u \rightarrow \infty} h_S(u; \hat{a}, v) = \ln \left[\frac{\cosh(\pi \hat{a}) - \cos(2\pi v)}{\cosh(\pi \hat{a}) - 1} \right]. \quad (160)$$

Thus, the energy saturates at large longitudinal separation. The logarithmic derivative is

$$\frac{\partial h_S}{\partial \ln u} = \frac{\pi(1 - c_v)u^2 \sinh \alpha(u)}{\sqrt{u^2 + \hat{a}^2} [\cosh \alpha(u) - 1] [\cosh \alpha(u) - c_v]}. \quad (161)$$

The strip running dimension is therefore

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, S_W}(u; \hat{a}, v) = 3 - \frac{\pi(1 - c_v)u^2 \sinh \alpha(u)}{\sqrt{u^2 + \hat{a}^2} [\cosh \alpha(u) - 1] [\cosh \alpha(u) - c_v] \ln \left[\frac{\cosh \alpha_0 - c_v}{\cosh \alpha_0 - 1} \frac{\cosh \alpha(u) - 1}{\cosh \alpha(u) - c_v} \right]}. \quad (162)$$

At short separation,

$$h_S(u; \hat{a}, v) = C_2(\hat{a}, v)u^2 + \mathcal{O}(u^4), \quad u \ll 1, \quad (163)$$

with

$$C_2(\hat{a}, v) = \frac{\pi \sinh(\pi \hat{a})}{2\hat{a}} \left[\frac{1}{\cosh(\pi \hat{a}) - 1} - \frac{1}{\cosh(\pi \hat{a}) - \cos(2\pi v)} \right]. \quad (164)$$

Hence

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, S_W}(u; \hat{a}, v) = 1 + \mathcal{O}(u^2), \quad u \ll 1. \quad (165)$$

The ultraviolet flow to one dimension again survives. At large longitudinal separation, $\alpha(u) = \pi u + \mathcal{O}(u^{-1})$ for $u \gg 1$, and the second factor in h_S approaches unity exponentially. More precisely, we find

$$\frac{\cosh \alpha(u) - 1}{\cosh \alpha(u) - c_v} = 1 - 2(1 - c_v)e^{-\pi u} + \mathcal{O}(e^{-2\pi u}). \quad (166)$$

Therefore,

$$h_S(u; \hat{a}, v) = h_S(\infty; \hat{a}, v) - 2(1 - c_v)e^{-\pi u} + \mathcal{O}(e^{-2\pi u}), \quad (167)$$

and

$$\mathbb{D}_{\Delta, S_W}(u; \hat{a}, v) = 3 - \frac{2\pi u(1 - c_v)e^{-\pi u}}{h_S(\infty; \hat{a}, v)} + \mathcal{O}(ue^{-2\pi u}). \quad (168)$$

The strip, therefore, reaches the classical value exponentially fast. The transverse gap π/W replaces the infinite-plane logarithmic infrared tail by finite-size saturation. The results above can be summarised as follows. The ultraviolet limit is local and universal, i.e. $\mathcal{V}(r) \propto r^2$ implies $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}(r) \rightarrow 1$. This follows from the finite T-duality core and is independent of the global geometry, provided the charge separation is small compared with both ℓ_0 and the geometric infrared scale. By contrast, the infrared behaviour is geometry-dependent. On the infinite plane, the potential grows logarithmically, and the running dimension approaches 3 only as $1/\ln(r/\ell_0)$. On the torus, the potential is bounded and periodic, so the flow saturates at separations of order L . In the half-plane and strip, grounded boundaries screen the neutral-pair energy, whereas in the strip, the approach to saturation is exponential due to the transverse spectral gap. Thus, finite volume and boundary conditions do not destroy the short-distance dimensional reduction induced by the T-duality kernel. Instead, they replace the infrared logarithmic divergence of the infinite plane with a finite, geometry-controlled saturation.

VI. CONCLUSIONS AND OUTLOOK

We have developed a finite-size formulation of T-duality-deformed electrostatics in $(2+1)$ dimensions. The main point of the construction is that the zero-point length ℓ_0 and the infrared geometry play logically distinct roles. The T-duality form factor $f(k) = \ell_0 k K_1(\ell_0 k)$ regularises the ultraviolet behaviour of the static Green function, whereas the large-distance behaviour is fixed by the spectrum, zero-mode prescription, and boundary conditions of the spatial domain. This separation is essential in two dimensions, where the ordinary Maxwell Green function is logarithmic and therefore carries an unavoidable additive infrared ambiguity. As a first step, we rederived the infinite-plane kernel in an explicitly subtracted form. Starting from the same static momentum-space propagator used in T-duality electrodynamics, the self-energy-subtracted neutral-pair interaction is given by (26). This result is finite at the origin, grows quadratically for $r \ll \ell_0$, and recovers the ordinary logarithmic Coulomb interaction for $r \gg \ell_0$. The derivation also shows that the T-duality kernel may be interpreted as a local Poisson problem sourced by the normalised algebraic charge cloud (18). This observation provides a useful physical interpretation of the ultraviolet regularisation: the point charge is replaced by a finite distribution with a radius set by ℓ_0 . The second result of the paper is a spectral formulation of the same nonlocal kernel on finite, bounded domains. If $A_B = -\Delta_B$ is a non-negative self-adjoint realization of the Laplacian on a domain Ω , with eigenpairs (λ_n, u_n) , the T-duality Green operator is $\mathcal{G}_{\Omega, \ell_0}^{(B)} = F_{\ell_0}(A_B)A_B^{-1}P_{\perp}$ with $F_{\ell_0}(\lambda) = \ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda} K_1(\ell_0 \sqrt{\lambda})$, and its kernel is represented by (42). This definition is not a formal restriction of the infinite-plane convolution kernel. Rather, the boundary condition is imposed before the nonlocal function of the Laplacian is formed. Consequently, different self-adjoint realisations of $-\Delta$ define different nonlocal electrostatic theories. This is the natural framework when the T-duality correction is interpreted as a function of the kinetic operator itself, as in the spectral treatment of nonlocal and fractional elliptic operators [15, 19–21]. The square torus gives the simplest finite-volume realisation. The constant mode must be removed, and this zero-mode subtraction is precisely equivalent to adding the uniform neutralising background required by charge neutrality on a compact space. For a neutral pair on $\mathbb{T}_L^2$, we obtained the exact positive mode sum represented by (77). The exponential falloff of K_1 makes the ultraviolet convergence manifest, while the absence of the zero mode makes the infrared sector finite. In the limit $L \rightarrow \infty$, with r and ℓ_0 fixed, the toroidal result reduces to the corrected infinite-plane interaction above. For domains with boundaries, the spectral construction also gives explicit closed-form results. In the grounded half-plane, the Dirichlet heat kernel allows the image representation (98) whose diagonal value is finite, and the boundary-induced force on a single charge is smoothed near the wall. Thus, the zero-point length not only regularises coincident charge interactions but also softens boundary self-forces. In the grounded strip, the same spectral construction admits both a transverse-mode expansion and a closed image-summed expression represented by (115). That formula reduces to the standard Dirichlet strip Green function when $\ell_0 \rightarrow 0$ and to the grounded half-plane result when $W \rightarrow \infty$. We also introduced an additive-constant-free running interaction dimension. The important point is that the diagnostic must be defined in terms of a physically neutral-pair observable, such as ΔV , rather than an absolute two-dimensional Green function. For the infinite plane, the result is represented by (128). In that case, $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}^{(\infty)} \rightarrow 1$ as $r \rightarrow 0$ and approaches the classical value 3 only logarithmically at large distance. In finite volume and in bounded geometries, the ultraviolet limit remains universal, that is $\Delta V(r) \propto r^2$ implies $\mathbb{D}_{\Delta}(r) \rightarrow 1$.

The infrared behaviour, however, is not universal. On the torus, the flow saturates at separations of order L because the potential is bounded and periodic. In the half-plane and strip, grounded boundaries screen the neutral-pair energy; in the strip, the approach to saturation is exponential, controlled by the transverse gap π/W . Thus, the short-distance dimensional reduction induced by the T-duality kernel survives finite volume, while the long-distance flow is determined by geometry. A useful by-product of the analysis is the clarification of the marginal infinite-plane limit. The corrected free-space result differs from the previously quoted expression for the same $(2+1)$ -dimensional static kernel [13]. The difference is not an additive choice of infrared normalisation, since it changes the electric field and the r -dependent part of the Green function. Nevertheless, the qualitative physical conclusion of that work remains intact, i.e. the T-duality scale removes the short-distance divergence of the planar electrostatic potential. What is modified is the normalisation of the potential, the coefficients of its asymptotic expansions, and the scaling formulae derived from them.

Several extensions are natural. First, the present construction should be extended to other self-adjoint realisations of the Laplacian, including Neumann, Robin, mixed, and interface boundary conditions. These cases are important for effective planar materials, where the boundary may represent a dielectric interface, an edge mode, a substrate, or a conducting environment. They would also test how much of the image intuition survives beyond the Dirichlet geometries treated here. Since nonlocal electrodynamics does not in general obey the same boundary rules as local Maxwell theory [16], this question is both mathematically and physically nontrivial.

Second, the formalism can be extended to other finite geometries, such as rectangles, disks, annuli, cylinders, and finite strips. In those cases, the spectral definition is immediate, but the resulting Green functions encode nontrivial geometry-dependent self-energies and forces. Disk and annular geometries are particularly relevant for vortex physics, mesoscopic samples, and quantum Hall droplets. Rectangular and toroidal geometries are natural for numerical simulations, where the finite-size dependence of $\Delta V_{L,\ell_0}$ could be compared directly with lattice calculations.

Third, it would be important to include genuinely $(2+1)$ -dimensional gauge structures such as Chern–Simons terms. A T-duality-deformed Maxwell–Chern–Simons theory would combine the ultraviolet softening studied here with topological mass generation and parity-odd response. This extension would be relevant for planar topological phases and quantum Hall systems, but it requires a separate analysis because the static propagator is then no longer a scalar multiple of the Laplacian Green function.

Fourth, the present work has been restricted to the static Euclidean sector. A complete dynamical theory requires specifying the Lorentzian branch of the operator $\ell_0\sqrt{\square}K_1(\ell_0\sqrt{\square})$, together with its retarded Green function, spectral representation, and causality properties. This is a more delicate problem than the static one because nonlocal form factors can be benign in Euclidean Green functions while requiring additional prescriptions in real time. Establishing unitarity, spectral positivity, or the precise domain of validity of the effective description remains an important open direction.

Finally, the scale ℓ_0 need not have the same interpretation in all applications. In a fundamental setting, it is tied to the zero-point length suggested by path-integral duality and string-theoretic T-duality [8–10]. In an effective planar material, however, it may instead represent an emergent short-distance scale, such as a lattice spacing, a coherence length, a screening length, or a nonlocal response length. The finite-size formulae derived here are therefore useful not only as consistency checks on T-duality electrodynamics, but also as a controlled phenomenological framework for studying regularised planar interactions in finite samples.

In summary, T-duality-deformed planar electrostatics is not completely characterised by its infinite-plane potential. The physically meaningful theory in two spatial dimensions requires both a zero-point length and an infrared prescription. The spectral construction developed here provides such a prescription for finite, bounded domains, yields explicit Green functions in representative geometries, and shows that the ultraviolet dimensional flow is robust, while the infrared behaviour is geometry-dependent.

Code availability

The codes used to produce the plots and check convergence are available at <https://github.com/dutykh/tduality/>

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